

Anaerobic Co-digestion of Food Waste and Glycerol in Single-Stage System

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List of Abbreviations

AD	anaerobic digestion
Alk	alkalinity
AMPTS II	Automatic Methane Potential Test System
C-GL	crude glycerol
CSTR	continuous stirred-tank reactor
FS	fixed solids
FW	food waste
GL	glycerol
HRT	hydraulic retention time
IPB	Instituto Politécnico de Bragança
MONG	matter organic non-glycerol
OLR	organic loading rate
P-GL	pure glycerol
TC	total carbon
TN	total nitrogen
TOC	total organic carbon
TS	total solids
VFA	volatile fatty acid
VS	volatile solids
WWTP	wastewater treatment plant

Acknowledgements

Abstract

The growing generation of food waste (FW) and the surplus of crude glycerol (C-GL) from biodiesel production represent two significant organic waste streams requiring sustainable management solutions. This study evaluated the technical feasibility of a single-stage anaerobic co-digestion system treating FW and C-GL as co-substrates, with the objective of verifying biogas production while providing a valorisation route for C-GL. The investigation was conducted in a 1 L continuous stirred-tank reactor (CSTR) operated under mesophilic conditions (35 °C) with a hydraulic retention time (HRT) of 30 days. Food waste was collected from a university canteen, and C-GL was obtained from biodiesel production residues; sludge from an anaerobic reactor from a municipal wastewater treatment plant (WWTP) served as inoculum. The reactor was operated in sequential phases: 1-an initial adaptation period, 2-co-digestion of FW and C-GL, 3-C-GL only feeding, and 4-a post-feeding period. Biogas production was monitored continuously using Automatic Methane Potential Test System (AMPTS II), while process stability was assessed through measurements of pH, total alkalinity (Alk), volatile fatty acid (VFA), and their VFA/Alk. Substrate characterisation included total solids (TS), volatile solids (VS), density, total carbon (TC), and total nitrogen (TN) analyses. Results demonstrated that Phase 2 (co-digestion of FW and C-GL) yielded the highest CH₄ production rates and cumulative volumes, with flow spikes immediately following feeding events indicating rapid substrate conversion. In contrast, phase 3 (C-GL-only feeding) resulted in reduced biogas production despite continued methanogenic activity. Total Alk remained elevated following bicarbonate supplementation, maintaining pH around 7 throughout most of the experiment; VFA concentrations fluctuated between 3000 to 5000 mg CH₃COOH L⁻¹, with VFA/Alk of 0.3 to 1.2. These findings support the hypothesis that C-GL can be useful for biogas production when co-digested with FW or alone. The study demonstrates the technical viability of anaerobic co-digestion as a strategy for valorising C-GL within a circular bioeconomy framework, though further research is needed to optimise C-GL loading rates and develop robust feeding strategies for industrial application.

Keywords: anaerobic digestion; biogas; crude glycerol; food waste; methane.

Resumo

A crescente geração de resíduos alimentares (RA) e o excedente de glicerol bruto (GL-B) proveniente da produção de biodiesel representam dois fluxos significativos de resíduos orgânicos que requerem soluções de gestão sustentáveis. Este estudo avaliou a viabilidade técnica de um sistema de codigestão anaeróbia de uma única etapa, tratando RA e GL-B como co-substratos, com o objetivo de verificar a produção de biogás e, simultaneamente, proporcionar uma via de valorização para o GL-B. A investigação foi conduzida num reator de tanque agitado contínuo (CSTR) de 1 L, operado em condições mesofílicas (35 °C), com um tempo de retenção hidráulica (TRH) de 30 dias. Resíduos alimentares foram recolhidos numa cantina universitária, e o GL-B foi obtido a partir de resíduos da produção de biodiesel; lamas de um reator anaeróbio de uma estação de tratamento de águas residuais (ETAR) municipal serviram como inóculo. O reator foi operado em fases sequenciais: 1—um período inicial de adaptação; 2—codigestão de RA e GL-B; 3—alimentação exclusiva com GL-B; e 4—um período pós-alimentação. A produção de biogás foi monitorizada continuamente utilizando *Automatic Methane Potential Test System* (AMPTS II), enquanto a estabilidade do processo foi avaliada através de medições de pH, alcalinidade (Alc) total, ácido gordo volátil (AGV) e respectiva AGV/Alc. A caracterização dos substratos incluiu análises de sólidos totais (ST), sólidos voláteis (SV), massa volúmica, carbono total (CT) e nitrogénio total (NT). Os resultados demonstraram que a Fase 2 (codigestão de RA e GL-B) originou as taxas de produção de CH₄ e os volumes acumulados mais elevados, com picos de fluxo imediatamente após as alimentações, indicando uma rápida conversão do substrato. Em contraste, a Fase 3 (alimentação exclusiva com GL-B) resultou numa produção reduzida de biogás, apesar da atividade metanogénica continuada. A Alc total manteve-se elevada após a suplementação com bicarbonato, mantendo o pH em torno de 7 durante a maior parte da experiência; as concentrações de AGV flutuaram entre 3.000 a 5.000 mg CH₃COOH L⁻¹, com AGV/Alc de 0,3 a 1,2. Estes resultados apoiam a hipótese de que o GL-B pode ser útil para a produção de biogás quando codigerido com RA ou isoladamente. O estudo demonstra a viabilidade técnica da codigestão anaeróbia como estratégia de valorização do GL-B no âmbito de uma bioeconomia circular, embora seja necessária investigação adicional para otimizar as taxas de carga de GL-B e desenvolver

estratégias de alimentação robustas para aplicação industrial.

Palavras-chave: biogás; digestão anaeróbia; glicerol bruto; metano; resíduos alimentares.

Chapter 1

Introduction

The generation of organic waste has become one of the defining environmental challenges of our time, particularly as urbanization and industrial activity continue to expand. A major contributor is food waste (FW), a global stream that in the European Union alone is estimated at 88 Mtonnes yr^{-1} , excluding inedible parts removed from the supply chain (Scherhauser et al., 2018). When considering only post-processing activities (wholesale, retail, food service and households) approximately 66.3 Mtonnes of FW are produced annually in the EU-27+1 (Albizzati et al., 2021). The scale of this loss highlights the urgent need for improved management strategies that move beyond simple disposal.

The environmental burden of FW is substantial. It accounts for roughly 15 % to 16 % of the total climate impact of the entire food supply chain, translating to about 186 Mtonnes $\text{CO}_2\text{-eq}$ of greenhouse gas emissions, alongside significant contributions to acidification and eutrophication (Scherhauser et al., 2018). The majority of these impacts arise during primary production, making prevention the single most effective strategy; however, when waste cannot be avoided, its valorisation through anaerobic digestion or composting is favoured over landfill disposal (Albizzati et al., 2021; Scherhauser et al., 2018). Despite this, much FW continues to be landfilled or incinerated, forfeiting the opportunity to recover its embedded energy and nutrients.

Parallel to the FW challenge, the rapid expansion of biodiesel production has generated an excess of another organic by-product: crude glycerol (C-GL). Formed in the transesterification of triglycerides, approximately 10 kg of C-GL are produced for every 100 kg of biodiesel (Garlapati et al., 2016). Global biodiesel output, driven by renewable energy mandates, has caused the glycerol (GL) market to swell with C-GL supply projected to reach about 6.33 Mtonnes by 2025, of which nearly 680 ktonnes are expected to be highly impure due to the shift towards waste-based feedstocks (Attarbachhi et al., 2023).

Crude glycerol composition varies widely depending on the oil source and catalyst used, but it typically contains methanol, soaps, free fatty acids, salts and other matter

organic non-glycerol (MONG) compounds (Anand & Saxena, 2012; Attarbachhi et al., 2023). These impurities are known to inhibit microbial growth and fermentation, as demonstrated by the severe reduction in 1,3-PDO production when untreated C-GL from jatropha, soybean or sunflower oils was used (Anand & Saxena, 2012). Purification to technical or pharmaceutical grade is energy-intensive and often uneconomical for small and medium biodiesel plants (Attarbachhi et al., 2023), prompting the search for direct, cost-effective valorisation routes. Because of its high organic content and ready biodegradability, C-GL has attracted attention as an ideal co-substrate for anaerobic digestion, where it can serve as a concentrated carbon source while being simultaneously detoxified by dilution and microbial synergy (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025; Tomczak et al., 2025).

Anaerobic digestion is a mature biological process in which consortia of microorganisms convert organic matter into biogas, primarily CH_4 (55 % to 65 %) and CO_2 , under O_2 -free conditions, passing through the sequential stages of hydrolysis, acidogenesis, acetogenesis and methanogenesis (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025). Anaerobic digestion offers a unique combination of benefits: it produces renewable, storable energy that can replace fossil fuels; generates a nutrient-rich digestate that can be used as organic fertiliser; and reduces the environmental load of organic wastes by avoiding landfilling and its associated CH_4 emissions (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025; Scherhaufer et al., 2018).

Within this framework, anaerobic co-digestion, the simultaneous treatment of two or more substrates, has emerged as a particularly effective strategy. Co-digesting C-GL with nitrogen-rich materials such as animal manure, sewage sludge or FW balances the C/N, dilutes potential inhibitors, provides essential macro and micro nutrients, and fosters synergistic microbial interactions (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025; Tomczak et al., 2025). The result can be a dramatic improvement in biogas and CH_4 yield: studies report increases ranging from 14 % to 226 % when C-GL is added to a variety of base substrates, with CH_4 contents generally exceeding 60 % as long as GL does not exceed about 8 % (v/v) of the feed (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025; Tomczak et al., 2025).

However, excessive GL loads can lead to volatile fatty acid (VFA) accumulation, pH drop and methanogen inhibition, underscoring the need for careful optimisation (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025; Tomczak et al., 2025). Overall, the convergence of abundant FW and surplus C-GL supplies, together with the proven capability of anaerobic digestion (AD) to convert these streams into renewable CH_4 and fertiliser, represents a tangible route towards a circular, low-carbon bioeconomy.

Chapter 2

Objectives

2.1 General Objectives

The primary objective of this dissertation project is to evaluate the efficiency of a single-stage anaerobic co-digestion system using organic FW and C-GL as substrates. The investigation will be conducted by determining biogas production, with a focus on industrial feasibility.

The central hypothesis is that the controlled addition of C-GL, a by-product of the biodiesel industry, helps biogas production due to its high energy content and rapid biodegradability, provided that adequate operational conditions are maintained to avoid VFA overload.

2.2 Specific Objectives

1. Characterize the substrates (FW and C-GL), evaluating physicochemical parameters relevant to anaerobic digestion.
2. Operate the single-stage anaerobic co-digestion system, assessing process stability.
3. Evaluate the techno-economic feasibility of using C-GL as a co-substrate, considering potential for industrial application.

Chapter 3

Literature Review

The rapid expansion of biodiesel production has generated an oversupply of C-GL, a by-product of the transesterification output, this Fig. 3.1 shows the steps to produce biodiesel and when GL is produced (Garlapati et al., 2016). This waste stream, loaded with impurities such as methanol, soaps, and hydroxides, the Fig. 3.2 shows the processes and what they contaminate the GL with, poses environmental disposal challenges, also with the variation of impurities depending on the source, there's no standard method to use this source of carbon (Anand & Saxena, 2012; Gebreegziabher et al., 2025). Anaerobic digestion aligns with circular economy principles by converting organic residues into biogas while recycling nutrients, making C-GL a promising co-substrate (Gebreegziabher et al., 2025).

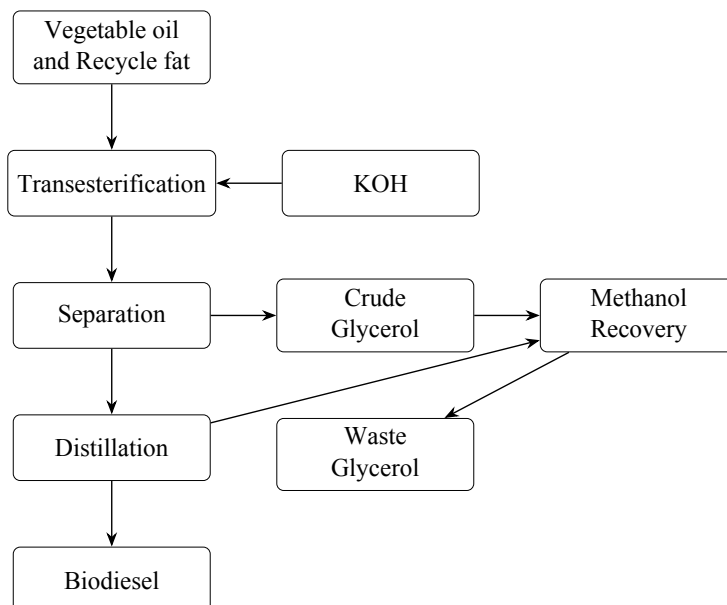


Figure 3.1: Crude glycerol from biodiesel production (Adapted from: Garlapati et al., 2016)

Gebreegziabher et al. (2025) reported that co-digestion of C-GL can boost CH₄ produc-

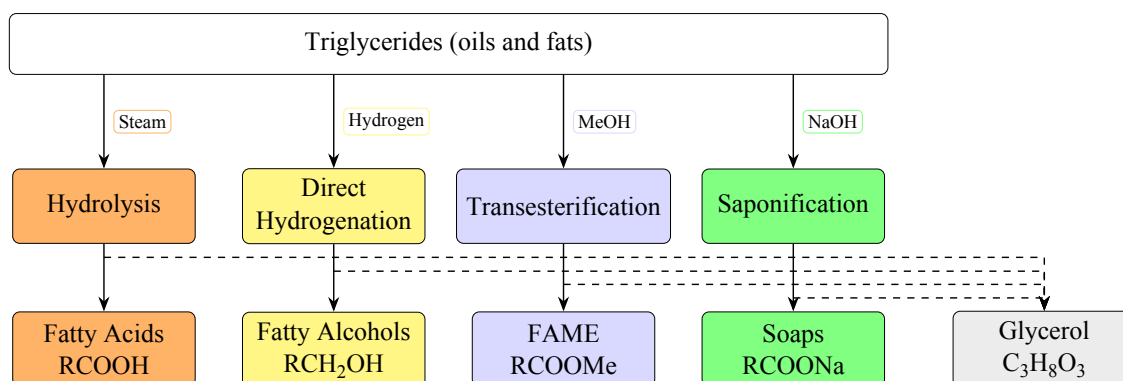


Figure 3.2: Contaminations of the crude glycerol (Adapted from: Attarbach et al., 2023)

tion compared to mono-digestion of the base substrate. Tomczak et al. (2025) reviewed one-stage AD experiments and concluded that a CH_4 content above 60 % could be consistently obtained when the C-GL fraction did not exceed 8 % (v/v) of the feed, the flow chart by Li et al. (2011) on the Fig. 3.3 it shows that using AD there could be up to 70 % CH_4 production. However, the same review emphasized that increasing the GL loading beyond a system specific threshold may provoke inhibitory effects, likely due to the accumulation of VFAs and the impurities present in C-GL (Anand & Saxena, 2012; Tomczak et al., 2025). The heterogeneous composition of C-GL, affected by oil feedstock, catalyst, and biodiesel processing, demands careful feedstock characterization and, if necessary, simple pretreatment to avoid process upsets (Attarbach et al., 2023).

Liquid AD, typically conducted in a continuous stirred-tank reactor (CSTR), operates at total solid concentrations of 0.5 % to 15 % and is generally used for treating sewage sludge, manure, and FW (Li et al., 2011). The CSTR's continuous mixing provides uniform distribution of substrates, microorganisms, and heat, which is essential when feeding a fermentable substrate. Temperature is a critical operational parameter; the activity of methanogenic consortia is strongly temperature dependent, and both mesophilic and thermophilic regimes have been applied to AD (Choorit & Wisarnwan, 2007). Tomczak et al. (2025) noted that the majority of GL co-digestion studies have been performed under mesophilic conditions, while thermophilic operation, which could offer higher conversion rates, still requires more systematic investigation. The CSTR platform is well suited to explore such temperature effects because its design allows easy control of heating and hydraulic retention time.

The selection of a robust microbial inoculum is decisive for rapid start-up and stable performance of a CSTR fed with GL. Anaerobic sludge from municipal wastewater treatment plants (WWTPs) is the most common source of inoculum because it harbours a diverse consortium of hydrolytic, acidogenic, and methanogenic microorganisms, the flow chart from Gebreegziabher et al. (2025) on the Fig. 3.4 shows each step of the AD until the

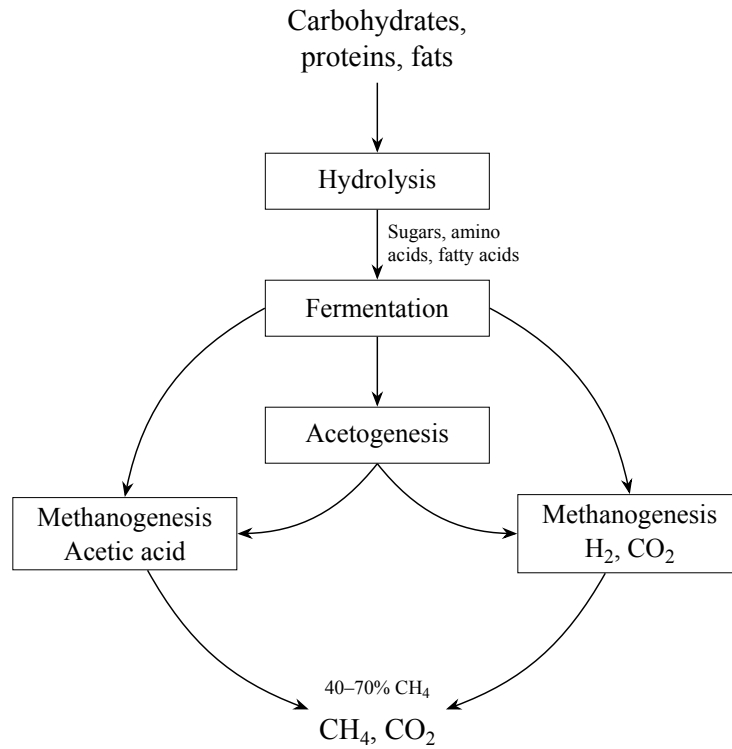


Figure 3.3: CH₄ production from anaerobic digestion (Adapted from: Li et al., 2011)

CH₄ production. Posmanik et al. (2020) demonstrated that granular sludge, obtained from up-flow anaerobic sludge blanket reactors treating wastewater, outperforms suspended biomass as an inoculum. Although their work focused on batch tests, the findings strongly suggest that using granular sludge from a WWTP as seed for a CSTR could accelerate acclimation, improve process stability, and reduce the risk of acidification during load increases.

When GL starts being degraded it makes the AD process susceptible to VFA accumulation and pH drop if the organic loading rate is not properly controlled. Therefore, close monitoring of process indicators is essential. Ribas et al. (2007) evaluated several methods for determining these parameters specifically in anaerobic reactors, highlighting the importance of accurate VFA and alkalinity (Alk) measurements for timely detection of process imbalance. Using the method from DiLallo & Albertson (Ribas et al., 2007) provide a validated method for measuring VFAs and Alk. Maintaining a favourable VFA/Alk is particularly critical when co-digesting GL, as excess VFAs can inhibit methanogenesis (Tomczak et al., 2025).

The available literature confirms that C-GL is a high-energy substrate that can significantly boost CH₄ production in liquid AD systems. A CSTR provides the mixing and temperature control required to harness this potential. Using granular sludge from a WWTP as the inoculum can enhance start-up speed and methanogenic activity, as demonstrated by

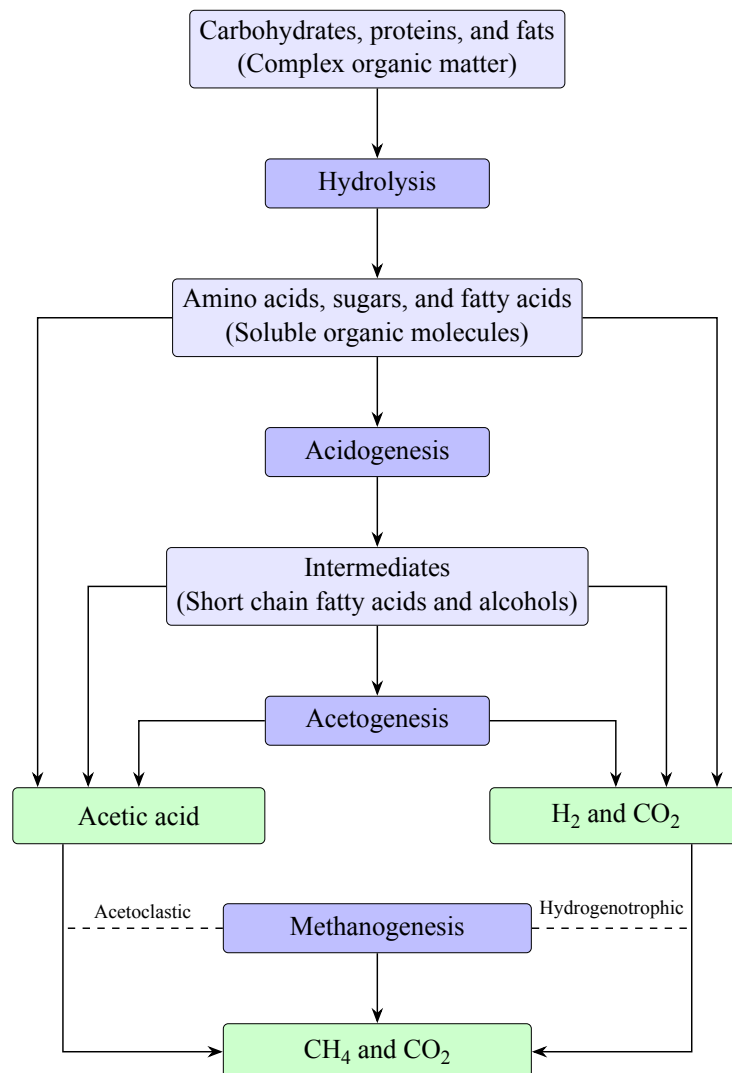


Figure 3.4: Steps to produce CH_4 from anaerobic digestion (Adapted from: Gebreegziabher et al., 2025)

comparative studies. To unlock the full benefits while avoiding inhibition, the GL loading must be kept below documented thresholds, and the reactor state should be continuously tracked through standard measurements of VFAs and Alk. Further research is needed to optimise thermophilic CSTR operation and to establish long-term performance data for granular-sludge-inoculated reactors treating C-GL.

Chapter 4

Materials and Methods

4.1 Collection and Preparation of the Food Waste

Food waste was collected from the canteen at the Instituto Politécnico de Bragança (IPB), prioritizing residues with high proportions of rice, pasta, and bread to maximize the sugar content and minimize the nitrogen content. The waste was diluted with approximately 2.5 L of distilled water and homogenised using a blender to obtain a liquid paste. It was then stored in a refrigerator at 4 °C to prevent spoilage and suppress microbial and fungal activity (Degueurce et al., 2020).

4.2 Crude Glycerol Collection

A 6 L bottle of C-GL, obtained from previous biodiesel production experiments at IPB, was provided for this study. C-GL from biodiesel typically contains impurities such as catalyst residues (Attarbach et al., 2023), which may influence its behaviour in anaerobic digestion.

4.3 Inoculum Collection

The inoculum was collected from a anaerobic digester from Águas do Norte wastewater treatment plant in Bragança. This ensured the availability of a microbial population for the anaerobic digestion (Posmanik et al., 2020).

4.4 Physical and Chemical Characterisation

The total solids (TS), volatile solids (VS), fixed solids (FS), and density were determined for the FW, C-GL, and inoculum. Total organic carbon and total nitrogen (TN) were determined for the FW and C-GL.

4.4.1 TS and VS Determination

Total solids and Volatile solids were measured using a sequential gravimetric method based on Standard Methods 2540 B and 2540 E (Lipps et al., 2023). The method involves controlled drying and calcination steps to quantify TS and VS fractions.

Initially, porcelain crucibles were placed in a muffle furnace at 550 °C for 1 h. For cooling, they were transferred to an oven at 105 °C for 15 min and then moved to a desiccator until they reached room temperature; their empty masses were recorded. For each material, a sample was placed into three crucibles and the wet mass was measured. The crucibles were then dried in an oven at 105 °C for 2 h (C-GL required 6 h to 8 h to reach constant mass). After drying, the crucibles were cooled in a desiccator to room temperature and weighed again to determine TS.

The same crucibles were subsequently placed in a muffle furnace at 550 °C for 50 min. Afterwards they were transferred to an oven at 105 °C for 15 min and then moved to a desiccator until they reached room temperature; the final masses were recorded to calculate VS.

Total solids, Volatile solids and Fixed solids were calculated as follows:

$$TS = \frac{M_{105} - M_{crucible}}{V_{sample}} \quad [g L^{-1}] \quad (4.1)$$

$$VS = \frac{M_{105} - M_{550}}{V_{sample}} \quad [g L^{-1}] \quad (4.2)$$

$$FS = \frac{M_{550} - M_{crucible}}{V_{sample}} \quad [g L^{-1}] \quad (4.3)$$

where M_{wet} is the mass of crucible plus wet sample, M_{105} is the mass after drying at 105 °C, M_{550} is the mass after ignition at 550 °C, $M_{crucible}$ is the mass of the empty crucible and V_{sample} is the volume of the sample. The volume is in L and the weight is in g. The results are on the Table 4.1.

Table 4.1: Total solids, Volatile solids and Fixed solids values

Sample		M_{crucible} (g)	M_{wet} (g)	M_{sample} (g)	V_{sample} (L)	M_{105} (g)	TS (g L ⁻¹)	Average TS (g L ⁻¹)	M_{550} (g)	VS (g L ⁻¹)	Average VS (g L ⁻¹)
Food Waste	1.000	7.873e1	1.060e2	2.726e1	2.550e-2	9.100e1	4.810e2		7.920e1	4.625e2	
	2.000	8.432e1	1.133e2	2.898e1	2.710e-2	9.887e1	5.364e2	5.364e2	8.474e1	5.208e2	5.208e2
	3.000	7.759e1	1.088e2	3.125e1	2.920e-2	9.344e1	5.420e2		7.818e1	5.216e2	
Crude Glycerol	1.000	8.422e1	8.864e1	4.424	5.000e-3	8.850e1	8.634e2		8.421e1	8.644e2	
	2.000	7.348e1	7.799e1	4.509	5.000e-3	7.786e1	8.677e2	8.677e2	7.347e1	8.687e2	8.687e2
	3.000	8.620e1	9.061e1	4.410	4.900e-3	9.050e1	8.713e2		8.620e1	8.724e2	
Inoculum	1.000	7.873e1	1.060e2	2.726e1	2.550e-2	9.100e1	4.810e2		7.920e1	4.625e2	
	2.000	8.432e1	1.133e2	2.898e1	2.710e-2	9.887e1	5.364e2	5.364e2	8.474e1	5.208e2	5.208e2
	3.000	7.759e1	1.088e2	3.125e1	2.920e-2	9.344e1	5.420e2		7.818e1	5.216e2	

4.4.2 Density Determination

Density was determined by a gravimetric volumetric method using graduated cylinders. Dry cylinders were weighed empty, then filled with distilled water at 20 °C and weighed again to verify the reading accuracy (density of water at $\rho_{20^{\circ}C} = 998.21 \text{ g L}^{-1}$). After drying, each cylinder was filled with a known volume of sample and weighed. The density of each material was calculated using

$$\rho = \frac{M_{\text{total}} - M_{\text{cylinder}}}{V_{\text{sample}}} \quad [\text{g L}^{-1}] \quad (4.4)$$

where M_{total} is the mass of cylinder plus sample, M_{cylinder} is the empty cylinder mass, and V_{sample} is the measured volume, the masses were measured in g and the volume in L. The results are on the Table 4.2.

Table 4.2: Density values

Sample		M_{cylinder} (g)	M_{total} (g)	V_{sample} (L)	Density (g L^{-1})	Average Density (g L^{-1})
Food	1.000	1.360e2	2.420e2	9.920e−2	1.069e3	1.068e3
	2.000	1.160e2	2.230e2	1.002e−1	1.068e3	
Crude	1.000	1.142e2	2.035e2	9.990e−2	8.932e2	8.931e2
	2.000	1.157e2	2.044e2	9.930e−2	8.929e2	
Inoculum	1.000	1.360e2	2.420e2	9.920e−2	1.069e3	1.068e3
	2.000	1.160e2	2.230e2	1.002e−1	1.068e3	

4.4.3 TOC and TN Determination

Total organic carbon, total carbon (TC) and TN were measured using a Shimadzu TOC-5000A analyser. Prior to analysis, the FW was diluted 400 X and the C-GL was diluted 800 X to bring the concentrations within the linear range of the instrument. The results are on the Table 4.3.

Table 4.3: Total carbon and Total nitrogen values

Sample		TOC (mg L^{-1})	TC (mg L^{-1})	Average TC (mg L^{-1})	TN (mg L^{-1})	Average TN (mg L^{-1})
Food	1.000	5.039	2.018e3	1.779e3	2.756e2	2.818e2
	2.000	3.927	1.540e3		2.879e2	
Crude	1.000	8.808	7.050e3	5.523e3	4.700e2	4.886e2
	2.000	4.992	3.997e3		5.072e2	

4.5 Experiment Configuration

The reactor had a useful volume of 1 L and was operated as a CSTR under anaerobic conditions. Mixing was provided by a magnetic stir bar, and the overflow exit tube was kept closed with a valve to maintain an anaerobic environment. As you can see in this Fig. 4.1:

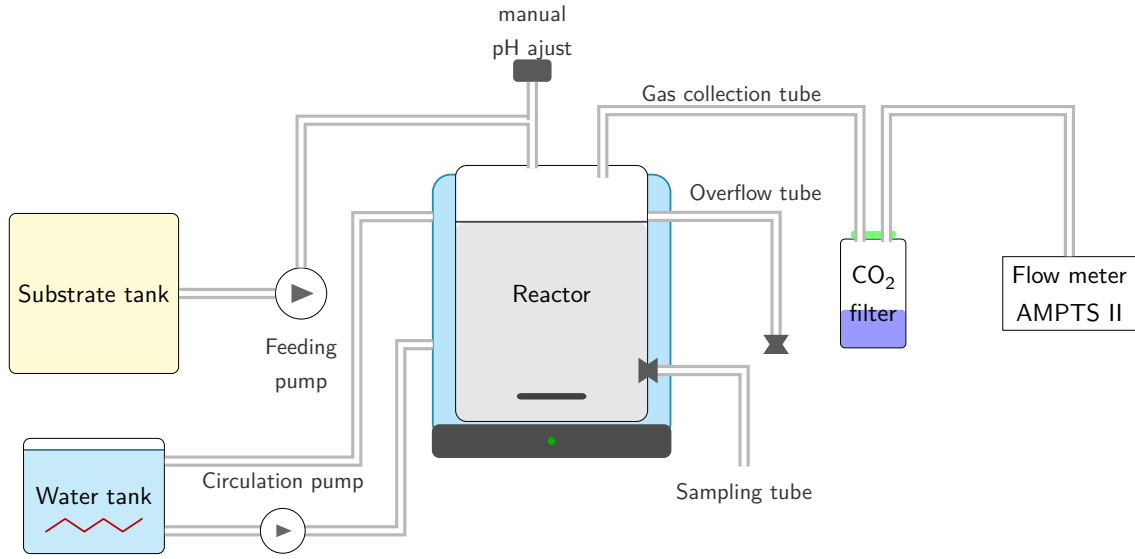


Figure 4.1: Schematic of the experimental setup used

The reactor was kept at 35 °C, close to the optimal temperature for mesophilic microorganisms (Choorit & Wisarnwan, 2007). The organic loading rate (OLR) was set with a max of 4 kg VS m⁻³ d⁻¹, with a hydraulic retention time (HRT) of 30 days, conditions for stable co-digestion of FW and GL (Tomczak et al., 2025). The pH was maintained around 7 by incorporating KHCO₃ into the feed solution at a concentration of 10 g L⁻¹, and adding KHCO₃ to the reactor whenever the pH dropped lower than 6.

The OLR and HRT:

$$\text{HRT} = \frac{V}{Q} \quad [\text{d}] \quad (4.5)$$

$$\text{OLR} = \frac{S_{\text{in}} \times Q}{V} \quad [\text{kg VS m}^{-3} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (4.6)$$

where S_{in} is the influent VS concentration (kg m⁻³), Q is the volumetric flow rate (m³ d⁻¹), and V is the reactor working volume (m³).

4.5.1 Feeding Solution

The feed was designed to achieve a C/N ratio of 25:1, which is optimal for AD (Li et al., 2011). Characterisation of the FW and C-GL showed that both substrates contained nitrogen, making it difficult to balance the C/N ratio using both of them together. Therefore, pure glycerol (P-GL) was used as an additive to allow precise control of the C/N. Based on the chosen HRT and the daily volumetric flow rate, the reactor was fed once per day to ensure a flow rate high enough to transport the solid FW suspension through the feeding tube.

The feed was made with a restriction of needing to have less than 15 % of TS%. The amount of OLR and if KHCO_3 was added, was decided by the pH and how was the CH_4 production of the reactor. If it was too acidic, it was used a lower OLR with KHCO_3 , if it was at the right amount it was keep the same amount, and if it was too basic it was added a higher OLR without KHCO_3 . The feed storage always had some remaining feed, and the new one was added on top, diluting or concentrating the feed going to the reactor.

The feed was also supplemented with nutrients to complement the feed and create a better feed for the microorganisms. Table 4.4 shows the nutrients used and there ratios.

Table 4.4: Nutrients used and there ratios, for a 25:1 C/N. (Adapted from: Alqudah, 2025)

Nutrients	Mass (mg L^{-1})
$\text{MgSO}_4 \cdot 7 \text{H}_2\text{O}$	5.400e1
$\text{FeSO}_4 \cdot 7 \text{H}_2\text{O}$	1.494e3
$\text{CoCl}_2 \cdot 6 \text{H}_2\text{O}$	1.200
ZnCl_2	3.000e1
$\text{NiCl}_2 \cdot 6 \text{H}_2\text{O}$	3.000e-2
EDTA	6.000e-1
$\text{CuSO}_4 \cdot 5 \text{H}_2\text{O}$	2.637e1

4.5.2 Biogas Quantification

The Automatic Methane Potential Test System (AMPTS II) system (hardware Fig. 4.2, software Fig. 4.3), was provided to measure the gas flow that was coming out of the reactor, with a CO_2 fixing unit using a solution of 3 mol dm^{-3} NaOH.

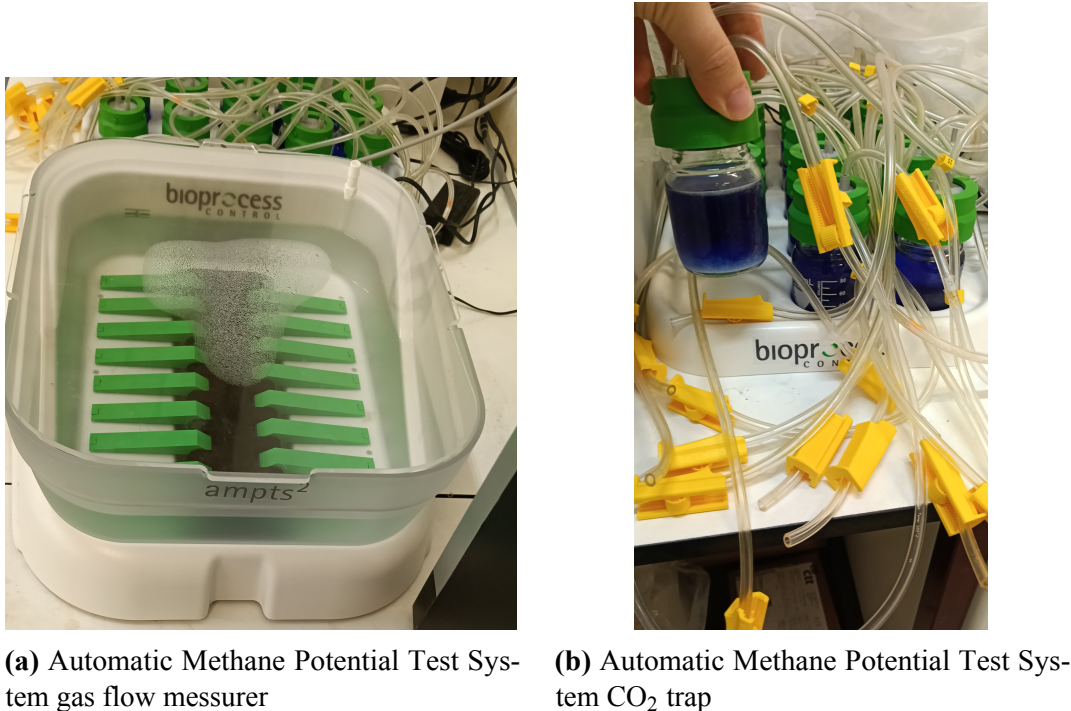


Figure 4.2: Automatic Methane Potential Test System hardware used

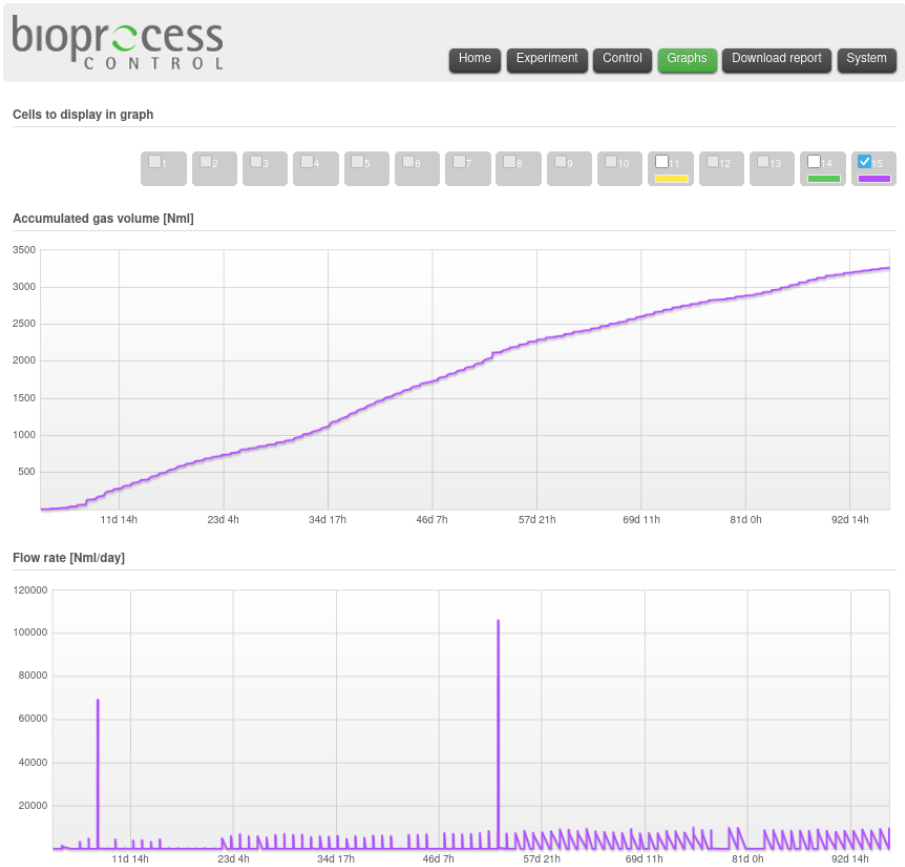


Figure 4.3: Automatic Methane Potential Test System software used

4.5.3 Analysis Methods

It was used the method of DiLallo & Albertson (Ribas et al., 2007), to measure the Alk and VFA. The sample collected was first centrifuged, at 2604 G for 30 min, to filter the particulated before doing the measurements.

$$TA = \frac{N_{acid} * V_{acid} * 50000}{V_{sample}} \quad [\text{mg CaCO}_3 \text{ L}^{-1}] \quad (4.7)$$

$$VFA = \frac{N_{base} * V_{base} * 60000}{V_{sample}} \quad [\text{mg CH}_3\text{COOH L}^{-1}] \quad (4.8)$$

The volumes were measured in mL, the sample volume was always 50 mL, the normality (N) of the acid and base, at first was 0.1, but then it was changed to 1. The Equation (4.7) is expressed in mg CaCO₃ L⁻¹, and the Equation (4.8) is expressed in mg CH₃COOH L⁻¹.

4.5.4 Substrate used as feed

Table 4.5 shows all substrates used to feed the reactor and when they were made.

Table 4.5: Description of the feed used throughout the experimental period

Day	Substrate 1	Substrate 2	Substrate 3	Extra Addition	OLR & TS%	Volume Made
0 ^a	FW, 156 g	C ₆ H ₁₂ O ₆ , 1.9 g		Ca(HCO ₃) ₂ , 5 g	1.5 & 15	500 mL
4	C-GL, 23.2 mL	P-GL ^b , 31.5 mL		KHCO ₃ , 1.9 g	0.8 & 10	250 mL
11	FW, 12.54 g	C-GL, 9.02 mL	P-GL, 2.6 mL	KHCO ₃ , 1.57 g	0.13 to 0.4 & 5 to 10 ^c	250 mL
18	FW, 10.88 g	C-GL, 2.89 mL	P-GL, 1.44 mL		0.0256 & 2	250 mL
25	FW, 31.12 g	C-GL, 44 mL	P-GL, 29 mL		1.4 & 10	250 mL
32	FW, 31.01 g	C-GL, 44 mL	P-GL, 28.9 mL		1.4 & 10	250 mL
39	FW, 46.52 g	C-GL, 66 mL	P-GL, 43 mL	KHCO ₃ , 2.6 g	3.1 & 15	250 mL
46	FW, 50.07 g	C-GL, 66 mL	P-GL, 43 mL	KHCO ₃ , 2.67 g	3.16 & 15	250 mL
53 ^d	C-GL, 55 mL	P-GL, 11.5 mL		KHCO ₃ , 5.38 g	0.42 & 10	500 mL

Table 4.5 continued

Day	Substrate 1	Substrate 2	Substrate 3	Extra Addition	OLR & TS%	Volume Made
60	C-GL, 55 mL	P-GL, 12 mL		KHCO ₃ , 5.18 g	0.42 & 10	500 mL ^e
67	C-GL, 41 mL	P-GL, 9 mL		KHCO ₃ , 2.56 g	0.95 & 15	250 mL
74	C-GL, 60 mL	P-GL, 12.5 mL		KHCO ₃ , 2.57 g	1.37 & 15	250 mL

^a It only started feeding on day 2.

^b The solution of P-GL was diluted 100 X.

^c The FW wasn't well mixed this day.

^d Change of substrate.

^e There was a leak on the feeding tube.

Chapter 5

Results

5.1 Reactor Condition and Visual Observations

The reactor was inoculated with anaerobic sludge and initially contained a murky, light brown suspension (Fig. 5.1a). Within three days of operation, the colour changed to black (Fig. 5.1b), which is characteristic of active anaerobic digestion and is typically caused by the precipitation of metal sulphides, particularly iron sulphide, under reducing conditions. This visual change indicated the establishment of a suitable anaerobic environment and the onset of methanogenic activity.

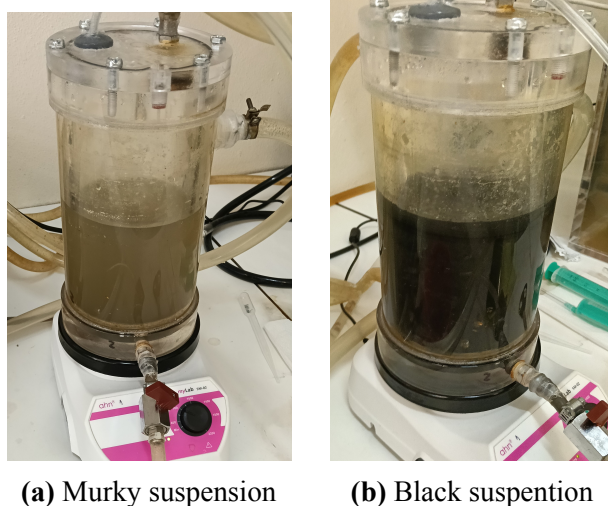


Figure 5.1: Visual changes in the reactor, within the first week.

At the end of the experimental period, after approximately two weeks of unattended operation, four discrete masses resembling fungal colonies were observed on the internal surfaces of the reactor during cleaning (Figs. 5.2a and 5.2b). The origin of these growths is uncertain, but they may have been introduced via the FW feed or during periods when

the feeding tube was opened for repairs (e.g. leaks) and when changing the feed that the tube had to be cleaned. The presence of such organisms could have competed with the anaerobic microbial community for substrate, potentially affecting biogas production in the later stages of the experiment.



(a) Masses inside the dry reactor

(b) Masses floating in the reactor

Figure 5.2: Visual for the masses inside the reactor.

5.2 Biogas Production

Biogas production was monitored continuously using AMPTS II, which recorded both the cumulative volume of CH_4 produced and the instantaneous flow rate. The entire experimental period is summarised in Figs. 5.3 and 5.4. To facilitate interpretation, the data have been divided into four distinct phases based on the feeding regime: (i) an adaptation phase 5.2.2, (ii) co-digestion of food waste and glycerol 5.2.3, (iii) digestion of crude glycerol 5.2.4, and (iv) a post-feeding period 5.2.5.

5.2.1 Overall Production

The cumulative CH_4 production over the whole experiment (Fig. 5.3) shows a continuous increase, indicating that the reactor maintained methanogenic activity throughout the monitored period. The total flow profile (Fig. 5.4) exhibits distinct peaks corresponding to daily production of CH_4 , with variations in amplitude reflecting the different substrate compositions and organic loading rates applied during each phase. And a outlier peak at day 53, that was when the feed was changed from a mixture of FW and C-GL, to only C-GL, and due to some complications, created an anomaly in the graph.

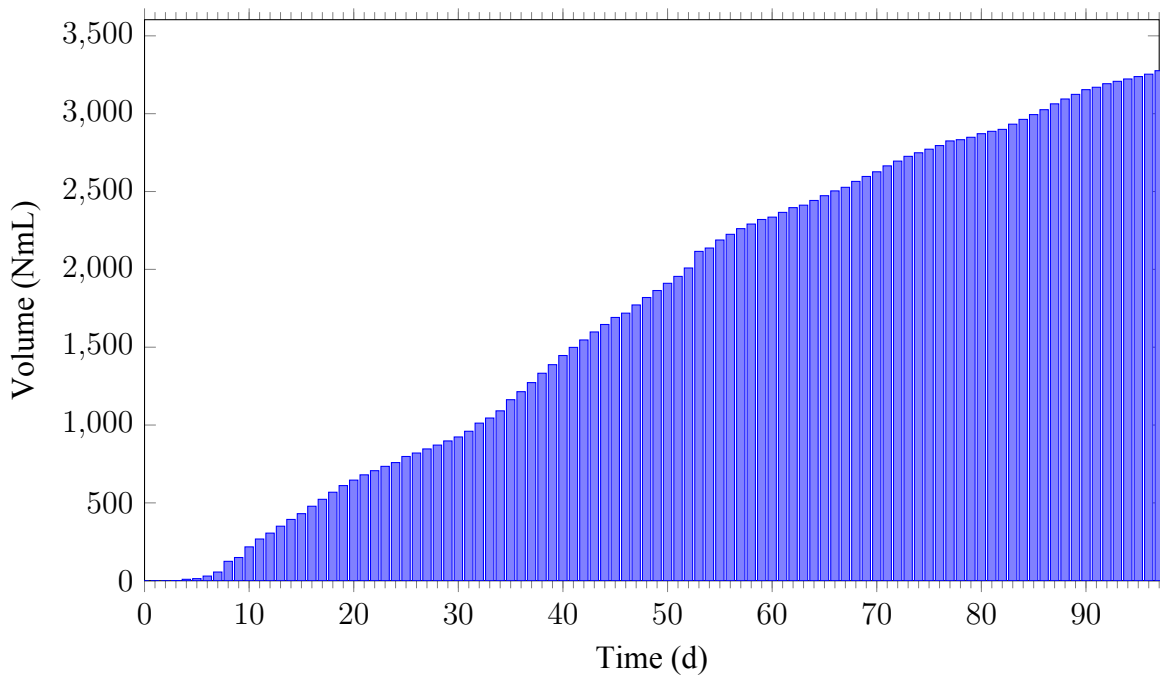


Figure 5.3: Cumulative volume of CH_4 NmL

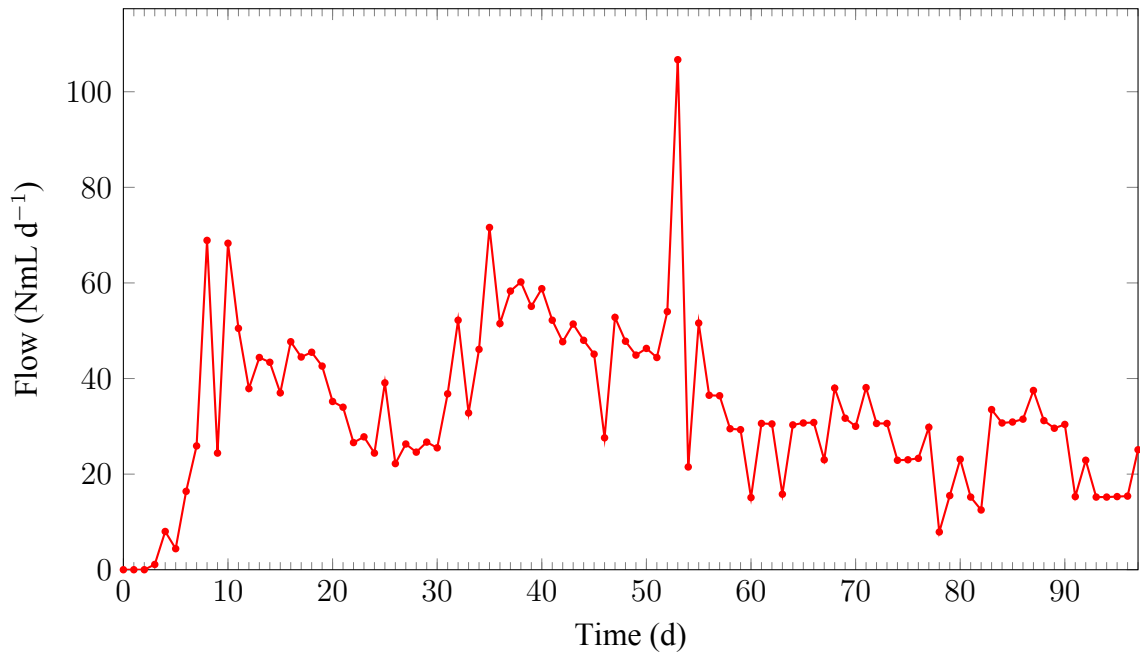


Figure 5.4: Volume flow of CH_4 NmL d⁻¹

5.2.2 Adaptation Phase

During the initial adaptation phase, biogas production was low (Figs. 5.5 and 5.6). This lag period is normal for anaerobic reactors as the microbial community adjusts to the new substrate and operating conditions. The small but measurable CH_4 flow confirmed that the viability of the inoculum, and the gradual increase in flow suggested the onset of exponential growth of the microorganisms.

The spikes seen on the days 8 and 10 (Fig. 5.6) probably happened by the first addition of C-GL to the feed.

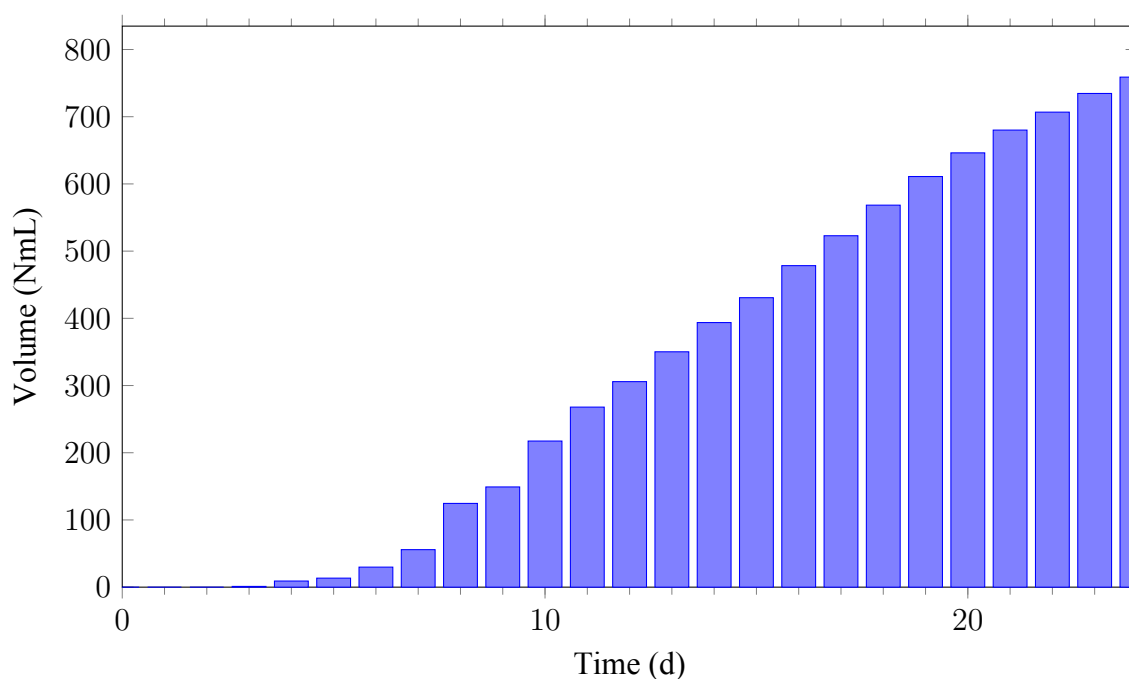


Figure 5.5: Cumulative volume of CH_4 NmL (Adaptation Phase)

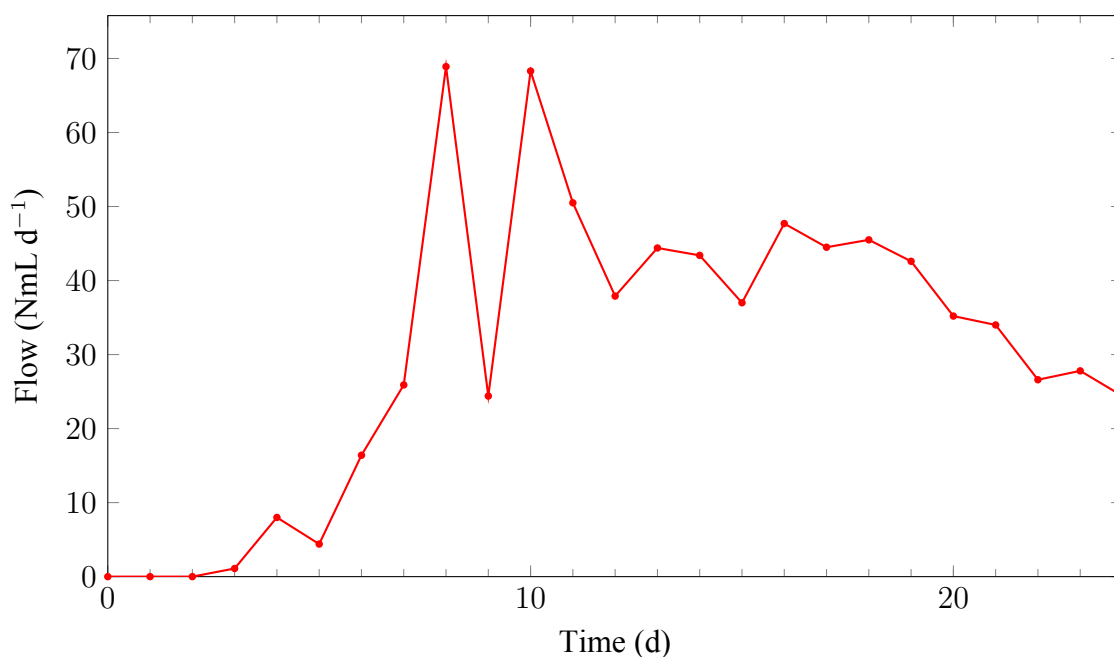


Figure 5.6: Volume flow of CH₄ NmL d⁻¹ (Adaptation Phase)

5.2.3 Co-digestion of Food Waste and Crude Glycerol

The reactor was fed with a mixture of FW and C-GL, a marked increase in biogas production was observed (Figs. 5.7 and 5.8). The cumulative CH₄ volume rose steeply, and the flow rate showed pronounced spikes immediately after each feeding event (Fig. 5.9). These spikes are typical of readily degradable substrates, which are quickly hydrolysed and converted to VFA and subsequently to CH₄. The average flow rate during this phase was higher than in any other phase, indicating that the co-digestion of FW and C-GL provided a balanced nutrient supply and avoided the inhibition often associated with high GL concentrations alone.

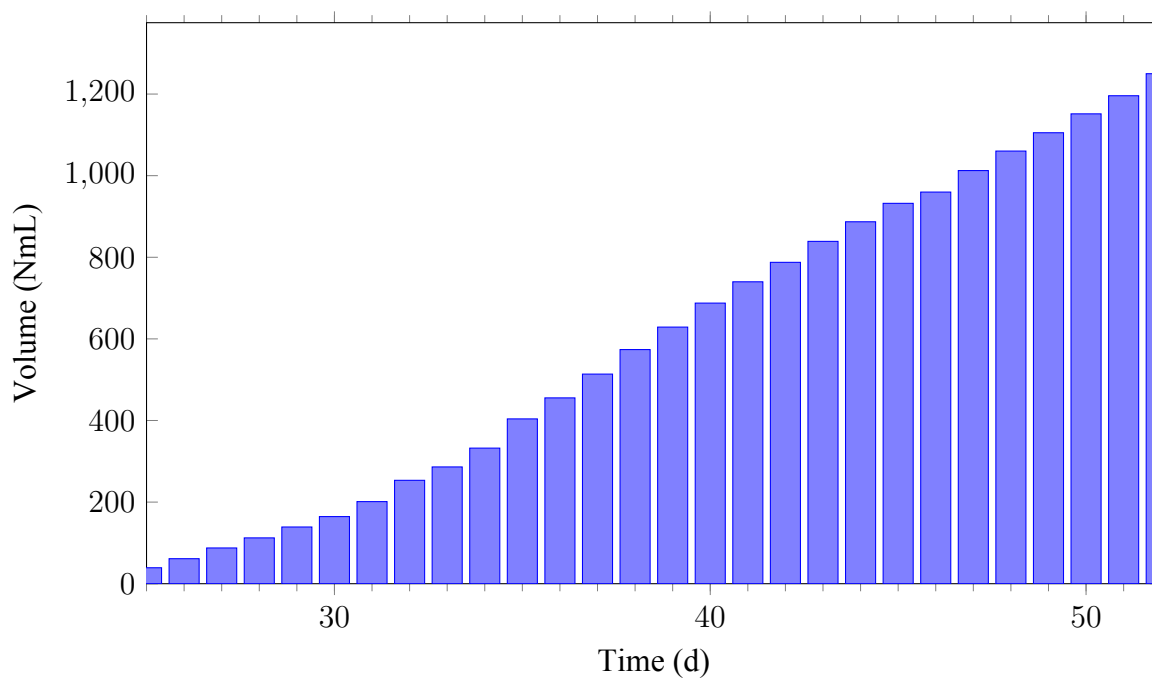


Figure 5.7: Cumulative volume of CH_4 NmL (co-digestion of food waste and crude glycerol)

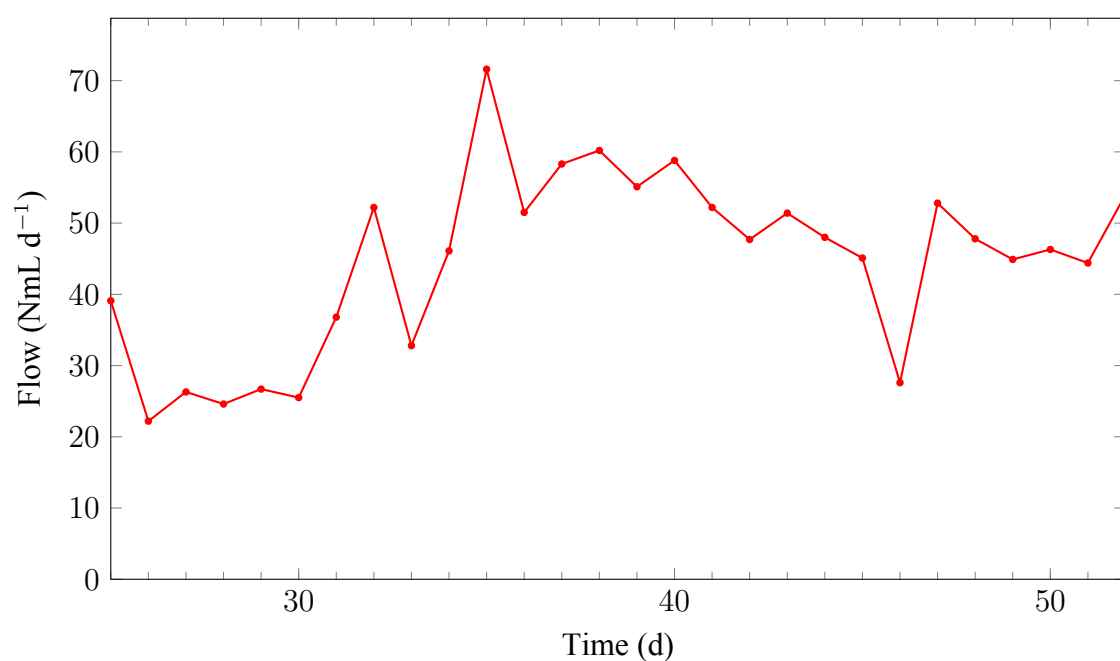


Figure 5.8: Volume flow of CH_4 NmL d^{-1} (co-digestion of food waste and crude glycerol)

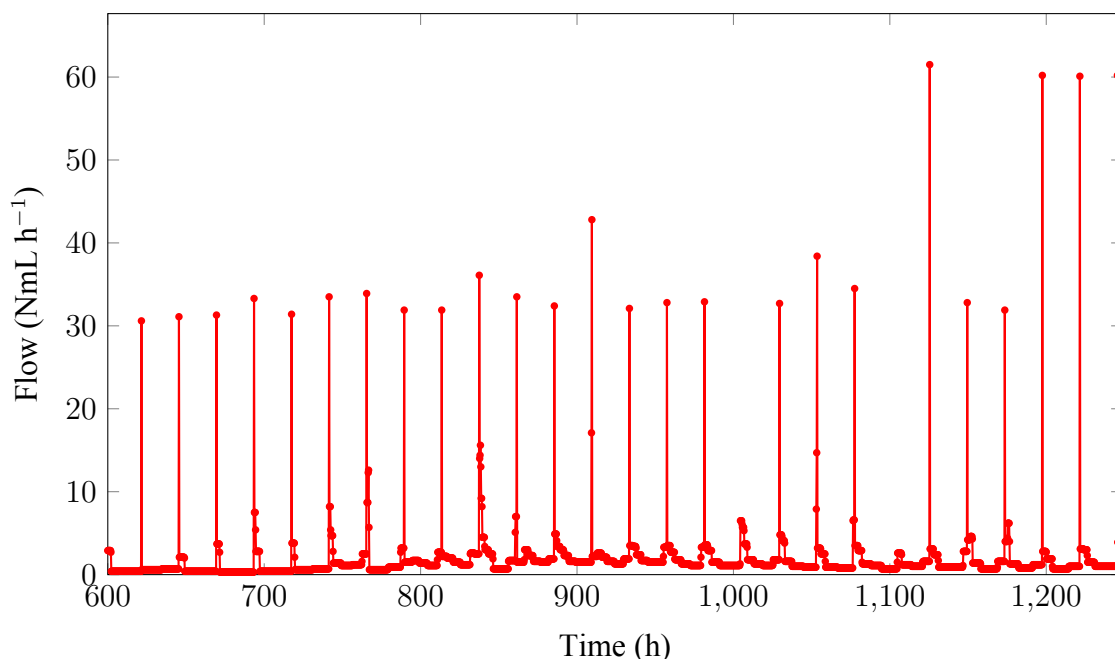


Figure 5.9: Volume flow of CH_4 NmL h^{-1} (co-digestion of food waste and crude glycerol)

5.2.4 Digestion of Crude Glycerol

When the feed was changed to C-GL alone, biogas production decreased (Figs. 5.10 and 5.11). Although spikes in the flow were still observed after feeding (Fig. 5.12), their magnitude was bigger than during the co-digestion phase, and the cumulative CH_4 volume plateaued more quickly. Several factors may explain this lower performance:

- The GL could have been transformed too fast or too slow, to maintaining a concentration of intermediate products.
- The retention rate of $\frac{1}{30} \text{ d}^{-1}$ may have been insufficient to wash out inhibitory by-products or to maintain a stable population of glycerol fermenting bacteria.
- The appearance of fungal masses towards the end of this phase could have further stressed the anaerobic community by competing for substrate or introducing toxic metabolites. The fungal masses could have helped digest more complex sugars, so without a more thorough investigation of what it was, it can't be said it didn't help the AD system.

For those factors, can't be said that this phase is worse than the co-digestion phase. If the experiment was done in reverse, it's likely that we would have seen a reverse on the results, were the phase with only C-GL would have a bigger production than the co-digestion of FW and C-GL.

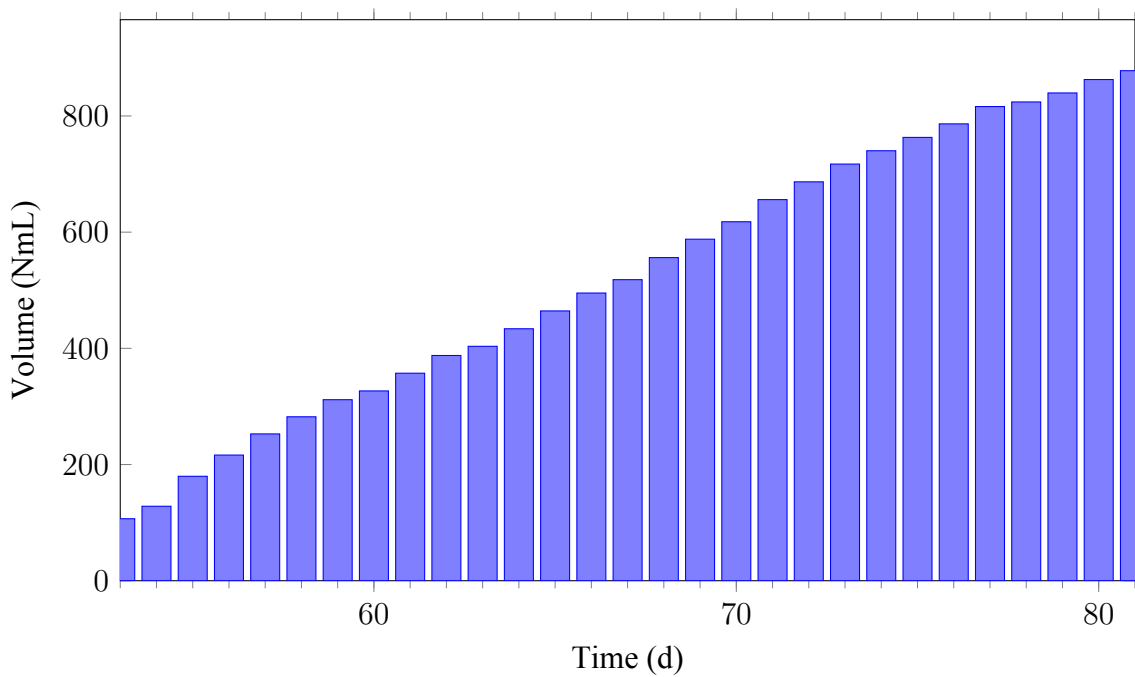


Figure 5.10: Cumulative volume of CH_4 NmL (Anaerobic digestion of crude glycerol)

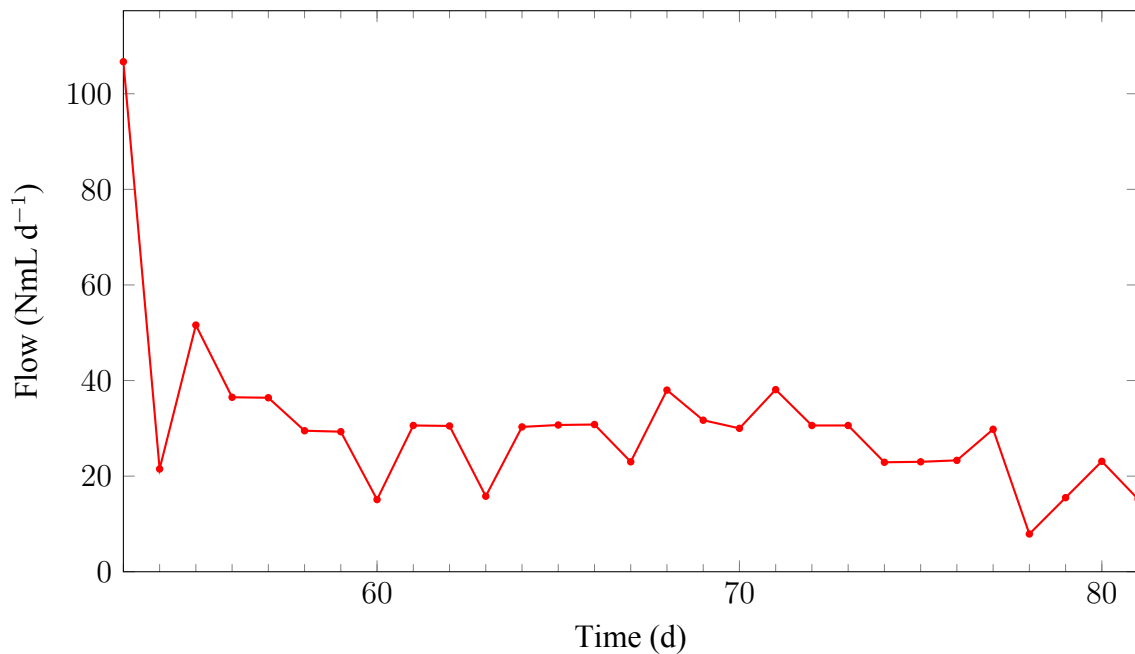


Figure 5.11: Volume flow of CH_4 NmL d^{-1} (Anaerobic digestion of crude glycerol)

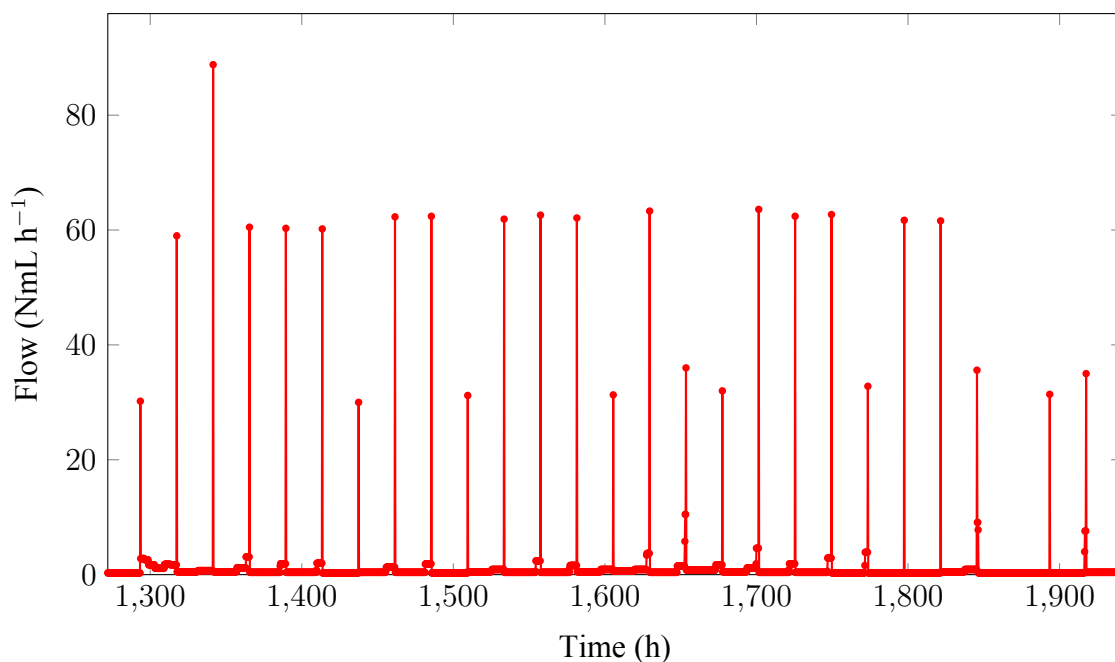


Figure 5.12: Volume flow of CH_4 NmL h^{-1} (Anaerobic digestion of crude glycerol)

5.2.5 Post-feeding Period

During the final two weeks, no fresh substrate was added to the reactor, it just had some residual substrate from the C-GL only phase for a week. Nevertheless, a small residual biogas production was recorded (Figs. 5.13 and 5.14). This production can be attributed to the slow degradation of accumulated organic matter and microbial decay products. The flow rate declined gradually, confirming that the reactor was no longer being actively fed and that the remaining substrate was limited.

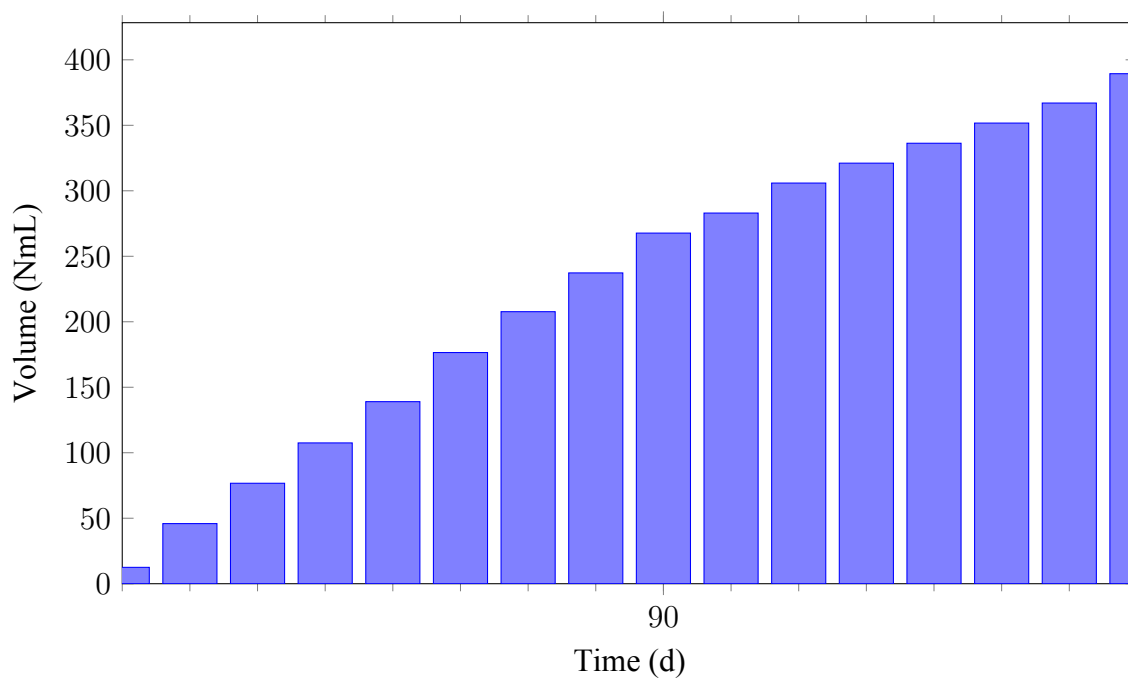


Figure 5.13: Cumulative volume of CH₄ NmL (Post-feeding period)

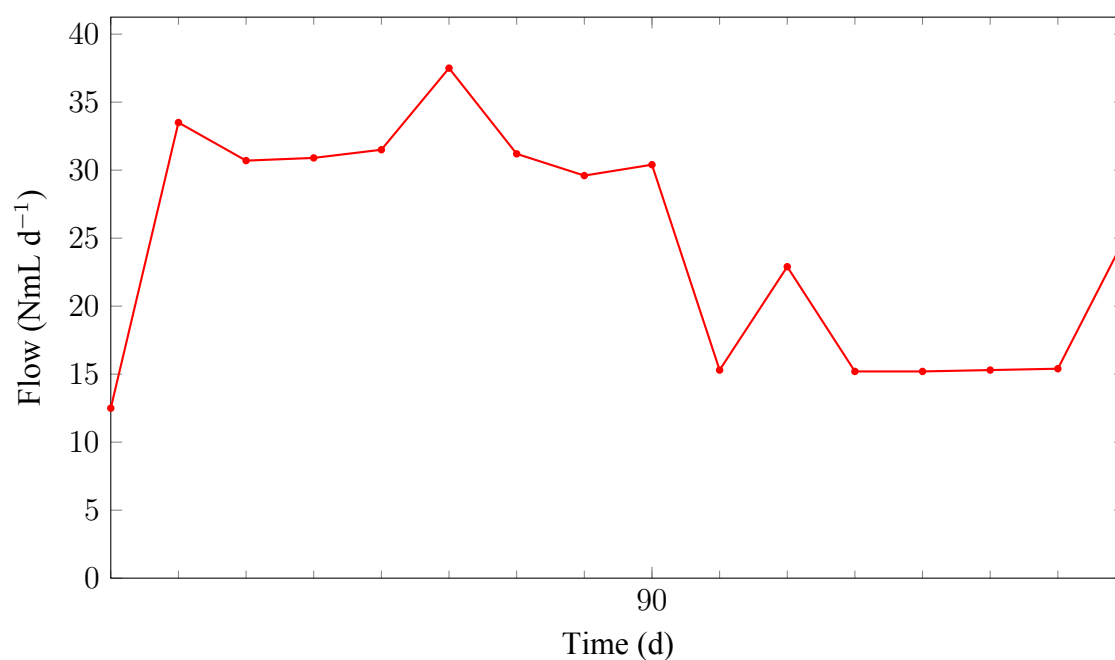


Figure 5.14: Volume flow of CH₄ NmL d⁻¹ (Post-feeding period)

5.2.6 Alkalinity and Volatile Fatty Acids

The total Alk and VFA concentrations were monitored throughout the experiment to assess process stability. The results are shown in Fig. 5.15. Initially, both Alk and VFA were low,

reflecting the early adaptation phase before buffer addition. After the manual introduction of KHCO_3 , Alk increased sharply to values above $7000 \text{ mg CaCO}_3 \text{ L}^{-1}$ and remained relatively high until close to the end. This high Alk was maintained by the addition of bicarbonate to the feed, which helped to counteract the acidity produced during the degradation of the feed.

Volatile fatty acid concentrations also increased after the start of feeding, reaching values between 3000 to $5000 \text{ mg CH}_3\text{COOH L}^{-1}$. Such high VFA levels are often associated with process imbalance, as they can inhibit methanogenesis. However, the high Alk provided a strong buffering capacity, and the pH remained above 6.5 for most of the experiment, with the co-digestion the pH was falling and with C-GL only the pH was increasing. The VFA/Alk is a more reliable indicator of instability. In this experiment, the ratio fluctuated between 0.3 to 1.2. While using the co-digestion feed a ration around 0.8 to 1.0 had the highest production.

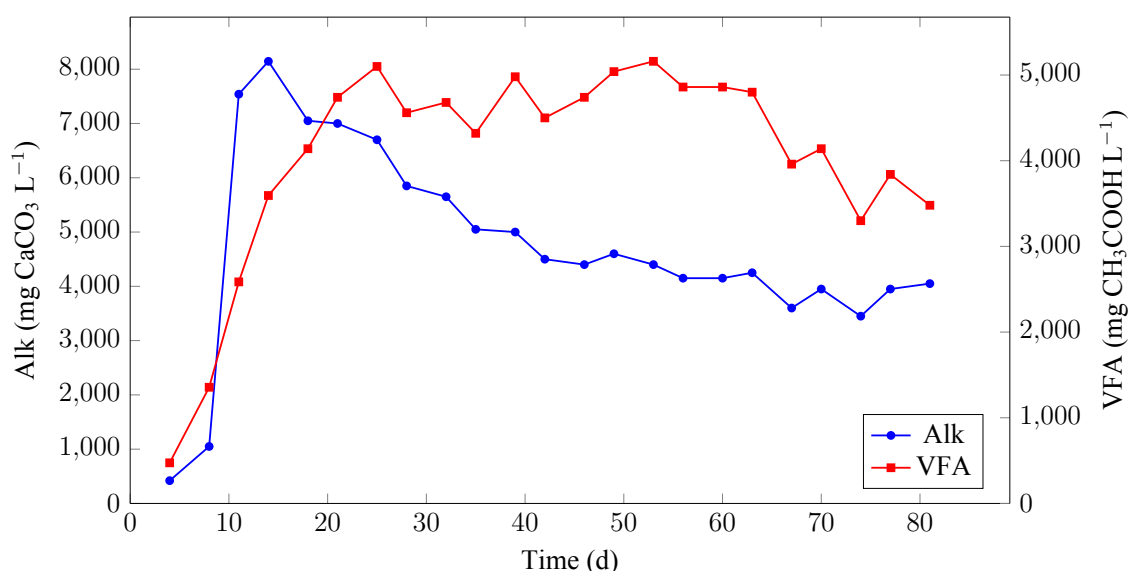


Figure 5.15: Alkalinity & volatile fatty acid comparison graph

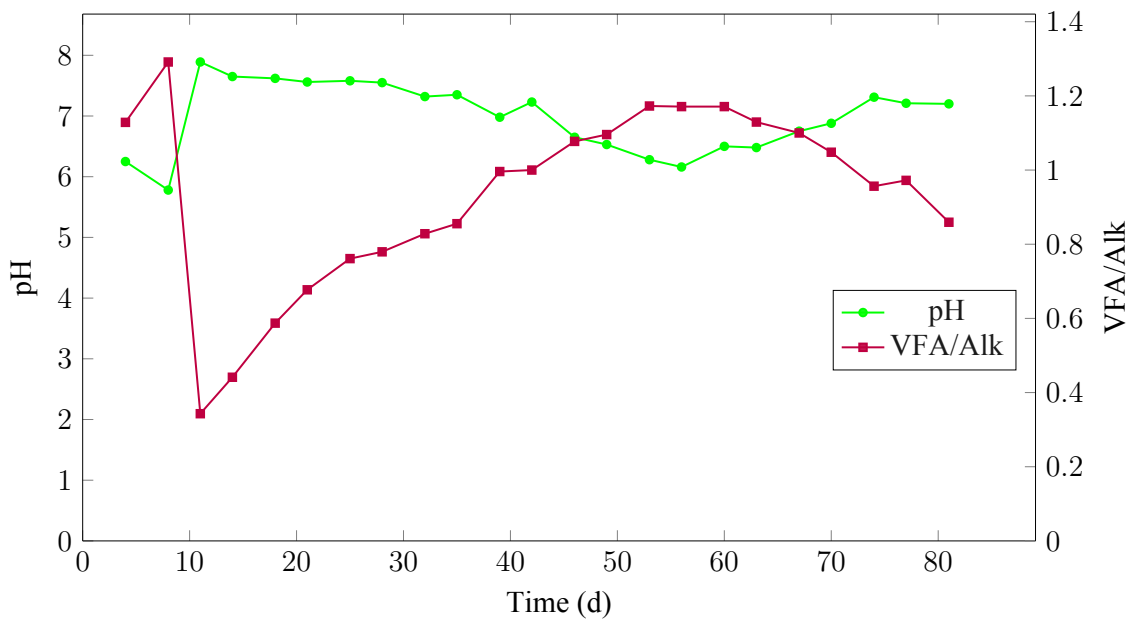


Figure 5.16: pH & VFA/Alk comparison graph

Chapter 6

Discussion

The CH₄ yield data obtained throughout the experimental period is summarised in Table 6.1, which reports the cumulative CH₄ production, specific yield, and volumetric productivity for each of the four operational phases. The cumulative specific CH₄ yield is calculated using Equation (6.4), while the daily specific CH₄ production rate is obtained from Equation (6.5). The volumetric productivity is derived from Equation (6.7), and the phase averaged values are computed using Equations (6.11) to (6.13). The overall yield for the entire experiment is given by Equation (6.14). These parameters are visualised in Figs. 6.1 to 6.3, which show the evolution of CH₄ yield and OLR across the four phases.

Table 6.1: Summary of the performance of the experiment

Phase	Days	OLR range (g VS L ⁻¹ d ⁻¹)	VS fed (g)	CH ₄ (NmL)	Yield (NmL g ⁻¹ VS _{fed})	Rate (L L _r ⁻¹ d ⁻¹)
Adaptation	0 to 24	2.560e-2 to 1.500	1.663e1	7.589e2	4.564e1	3.040e-2
Co-digestion	25 to 52	1.400 to 3.160	6.342e1	1.250e3	1.971e1	4.460e-2
C-GL only	53 to 81	4.200e-1 to 1.370	2.349e1	8.779e2	3.737e1	3.030e-2
Post-feeding	82 to 97	0.000 to 1.370	9.590	3.894e2	4.060e1	2.450e-2

The overall cumulative CH₄ production reached 3276.1 NmL, corresponding to an overall yield of approximately 28.96 NmL CH₄ g⁻¹ VS_{fed} (calculated using Equation (6.14)). This value is considerably lower than the yields reported in the literature for similar substrates. Gebreegziabher et al. (2025) reviewed the AD of biodiesel byproducts and reported CH₄ yield enhancements ranging from 14 % to 226 % when C-GL is co-digested with various substrates. Tomczak et al. (2025) analysed data from multiple studies and concluded that CH₄ content in biogas exceeds 60 % when the C-GL fraction in the feedstock is kept below 8 % (v/v). In the present study, the C-GL fraction varied across phases, but the

overall CH₄ yield remained below the values typically reported for C-GL co-digestion. This discrepancy may be attributed to the single-stage configuration, the specific characteristics of the FW and GL used, and the process instability observed during the end of the co-digestion phase and the start of the GL-only phase.

During the adaptation phase (days 0 to 24), the specific CH₄ yield reached 45.64 NmL CH₄ g⁻¹ VS_{fed}, the highest among all phases. However, this value must be interpreted with caution, as the cumulative VS fed during this period was only 16.628 g, and CH₄ production was still in the early stages of development. The volumetric productivity was 0.0304 L L_r⁻¹ d⁻¹. The daily yield profile in Fig. 6.2 shows a gradual increase in CH₄ production during this phase, with a notable spike around day 8, corresponding to the first addition of C-GL to the feed. This observation is consistent with Gebreegziabher et al. (2025), who noted that C-GL is readily biodegradable and can stimulate methanogenic activity when introduced to an acclimated microbial community.

In the co-digestion phase (days 25 to 52), the OLR was increased from 1.4 g VS L⁻¹ d⁻¹ to 3.16 g VS L⁻¹ d⁻¹, and the cumulative CH₄ production reached 1249.9 NmL. The specific yield decreased to 19.71 NmL CH₄ g⁻¹ VS_{fed}, while the volumetric productivity increased to 0.0446 L L_r⁻¹ d⁻¹, the highest of all phases. This inverse relationship between specific yield and volumetric productivity reflects the higher organic loading rate applied, which promoted greater CH₄ production per reactor volume but reduced the efficiency of substrate conversion to CH₄. The daily yield profile in Fig. 6.2 exhibits fluctuations during this phase, this pattern is typical of readily degradable substrates and has been reported by Tomczak et al. (2025) and Srimachai et al. (2025). Srimachai et al. (2025) investigated the co-digestion of canned seafood wastewater with GL waste and reported CH₄ yields of 345 mL CH₄ g⁻¹ COD at a mixing ratio of 96.4 % (v/v). Although the substrate characteristics differ, the general trend of enhanced CH₄ production during co-digestion is consistent with the present findings.

The C-GL only phase (days 53 to 81) exhibited a specific yield of 37.37 NmL CH₄ g⁻¹ VS_{fed} and a volumetric productivity of 0.0303 L L_r⁻¹ d⁻¹, with a cumulative CH₄ production of 877.9 NmL. The OLR ranged from 0.42 g VS L⁻¹ d⁻¹ to 1.37 g VS L⁻¹ d⁻¹. Despite the absence of FW in the feed, CH₄ production continued, indicating that the microbial community had adapted to GL as a sole carbon source. However, the specific yield was lower than during the adaptation phase, suggesting that GL alone may not provide an optimal nutrient balance for methanogenesis. Tomczak et al. (2025) emphasised that C-GL is an ideal co-substrate but can cause inhibition when used alone or at high concentrations due to the accumulation of VFAs and the presence of impurities such as methanol, soaps, and heavy metals. The daily yield profile in Fig. 6.2 shows a declining trend during this phase, with a notable outlier peak at day 53, corresponding to the transition from co-digestion to

GL-only feeding. This anomaly, also visible in Fig. 6.3, was caused by problems during the change.

The post-feeding phase (days 82 to 97) produced 389.4 NmL of CH₄, with a specific yield of 40.60 NmL CH₄ g⁻¹ VS_{fed} and a volumetric productivity of 0.0245 L L_r⁻¹ d⁻¹. The OLR got to zero during this period, and the CH₄ produced can be attributed to the slow degradation of residual organic matter and microbial decay products. The daily yield profile in Fig. 6.2 shows a gradual decline, confirming that the reactor was no longer being actively fed and that the remaining substrate was limited.

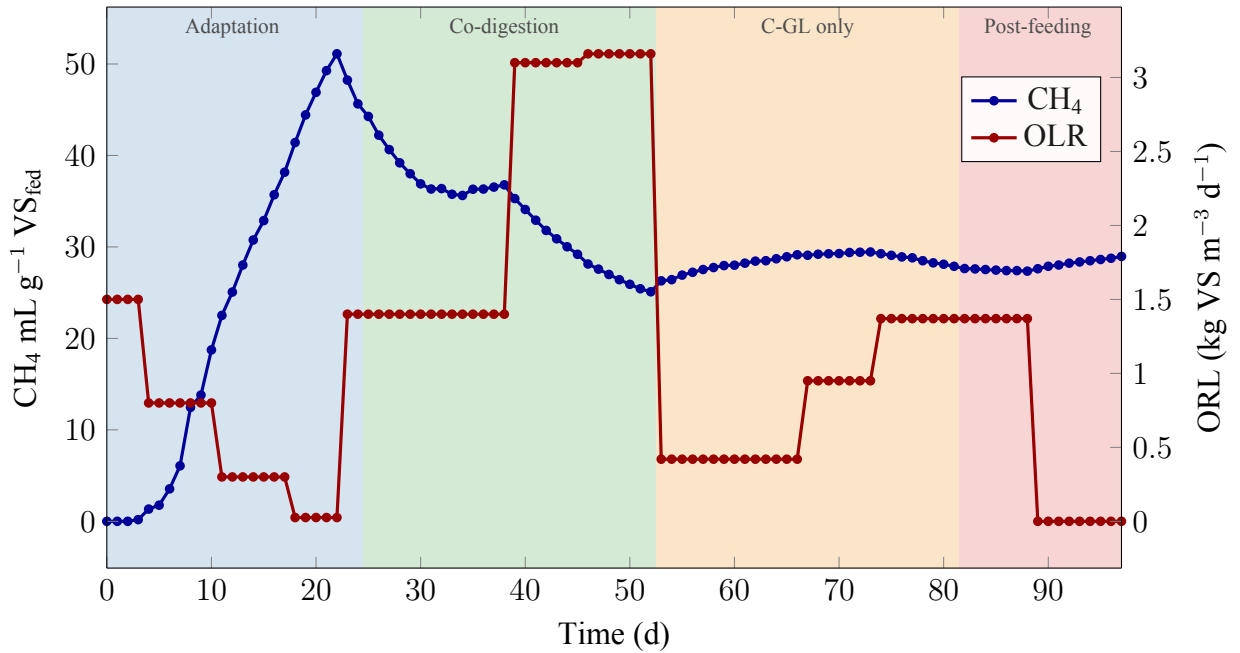


Figure 6.1: Cumulative specific CH₄ yield

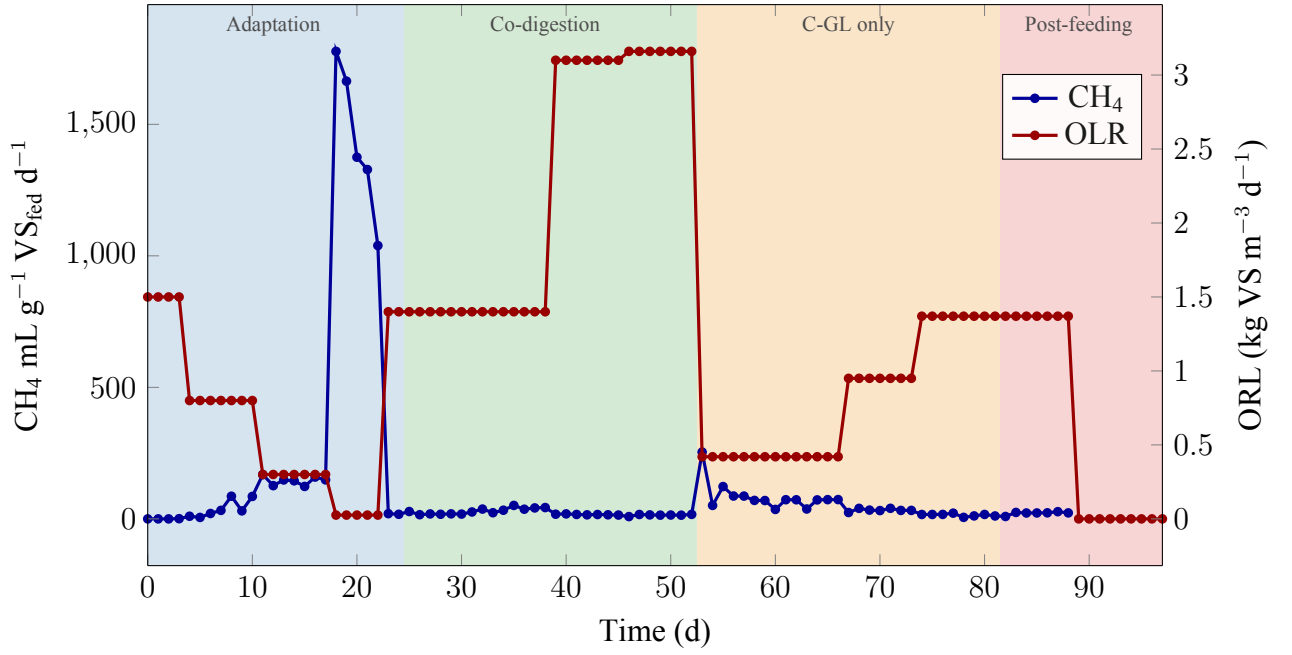


Figure 6.2: Daily yield of CH₄

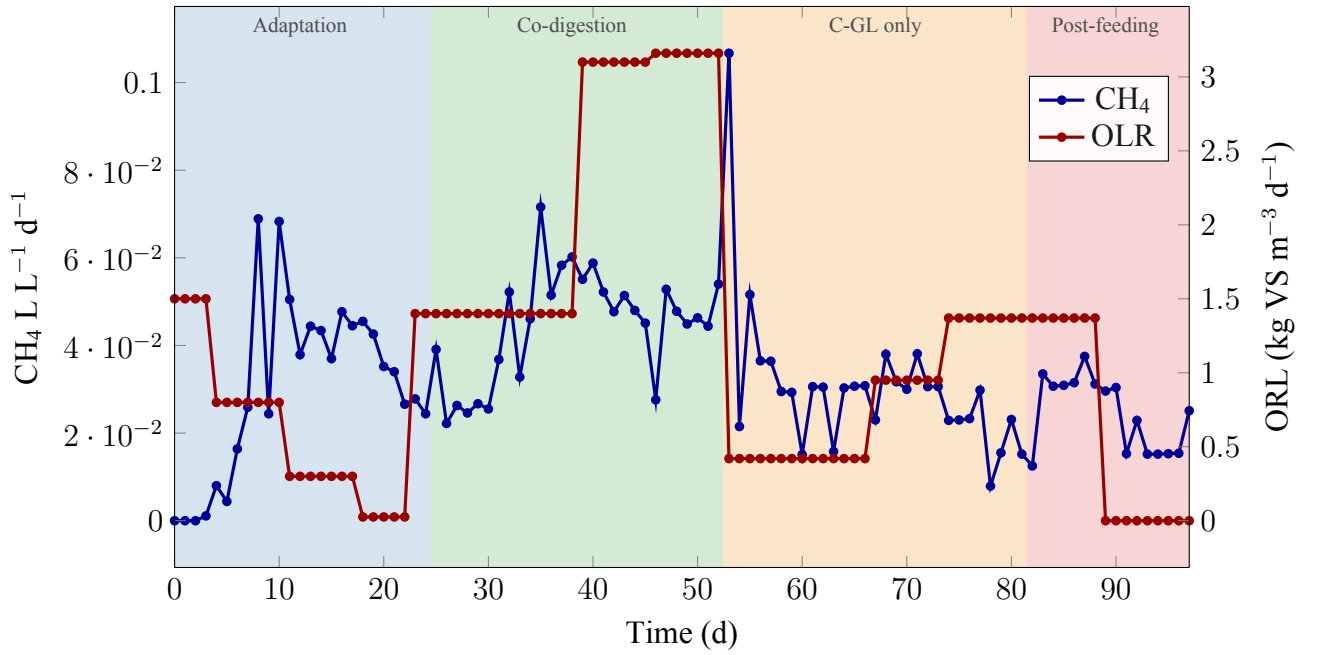


Figure 6.3: Volumetric productivity of CH₄

$$Q = \frac{V_r}{\text{HRT}} \quad [\text{m}^3 \text{d}^{-1}] \quad (6.1)$$

$$m_{\text{VS,day}} = \text{OLR} \cdot V_r \quad [\text{g d}^{-1}] \quad (6.2)$$

$$M_{VS}(n) = \sum_{i=0}^n m_{VS,day}(i) \quad [\text{g}] \quad (6.3)$$

$$Y(n) = \frac{V_{CH_4}(n)}{M_{VS}(n)} \quad [\text{NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}] \quad (6.4)$$

$$r_{CH_4}(n) = \frac{F_{CH_4}(n)}{m_{VS,day}(n)} \quad [\text{mL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (6.5)$$

$$\dot{n}_{CH_4}(n) = \frac{F_{CH_4}(n)}{V_m \cdot V_r} \quad [\text{mol CH}_4 \text{ m}^{-3} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (6.6)$$

$$\dot{V}_{CH_4}(n) = \frac{F_{CH_4}(n)}{1000 \cdot V_r} \quad [\text{L CH}_4 \text{ L}_r^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (6.7)$$

$$\Delta V_{CH_4}(a, b) = V_{CH_4}(b) - V_{CH_4}(a - 1) \quad [\text{NmL}] \quad (6.8)$$

$$\Delta M_{VS}(a, b) = M_{VS}(b) - M_{VS}(a - 1) \quad [\text{g}] \quad (6.9)$$

$$Y(a, b) = \frac{\Delta V_{CH_4}(a, b)}{\Delta M_{VS}(a, b)} \quad [\text{NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}] \quad (6.10)$$

$$\overline{\dot{n}_{CH_4}}(a, b) = \frac{1}{b - a + 1} \sum_{n=a}^b \dot{n}_{CH_4}(n) \quad [\text{mol CH}_4 \text{ m}^{-3} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (6.11)$$

$$\overline{\dot{V}_{CH_4}}(a, b) = \frac{1}{b - a + 1} \sum_{n=a}^b \dot{V}_{CH_4}(n) \quad [\text{L CH}_4 \text{ L}_r^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (6.12)$$

$$\overline{r_{CH_4}}(a, b) = \frac{1}{b - a + 1} \sum_{n=a}^b r_{CH_4}(n) \quad [\text{mL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}} \text{ d}^{-1}] \quad (6.13)$$

$$Y_{\text{overall}} = \frac{V_{CH_4}(N_f)}{M_{VS}(N_f)} \quad [\text{NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}] \quad (6.14)$$

Comparisons with the literature reveal that the CH_4 yields obtained in this experiment are lower than those reported for similar co-digestion systems. Aguiar et al. (2026) investigated the co-digestion of sugarcane vinasse and cattle manure in a semi-continuous stirred-tank reactor and reported volumetric CH_4 productivities of $3981 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ L}^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}$ to $5269 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ L}^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}$ for mixing ratios of 5:1 and 1:1 (v/m), respectively, at OLRs of $1.7 \text{ kg VS m}^{-3} \text{ d}^{-1}$ to $4.1 \text{ kg VS m}^{-3} \text{ d}^{-1}$. These values are two orders of magnitude higher than the maximum volumetric productivity of $44.6 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ L}^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}$ obtained in

the present study. The large difference is primarily due to the much higher OLR applied by Aguiar et al. (2026) and the different substrate characteristics. Aguiar et al. (2026) also reported that the addition of GL as a supplementary organic substrate compromised system stability, which is consistent with the VFA accumulation and pH fluctuations observed in the present study during the co-digestion phase.

Longanesi (2016) reported CH_4 yields from grape pomace digestion ranging from $20.4 \text{ NL CH}_4 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ VS}$ in batch mode to $160 \text{ NL CH}_4 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ VS}$ in continuous mode at an OLR of $0.4 \text{ g VS L}^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}$. The continuous-mode yield of $160 \text{ NL CH}_4 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ VS}$ is equivalent to $160 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}$, which is higher than the overall yield of $28.96 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}$ obtained in this experiment. However, it should be noted that Longanesi (2016) used grape pomace as the sole substrate, whereas the present experiment used a mixture of FW and C-GL. Longanesi (2016) also reported that co-digestion of grape pomace with maize silage improved the CH_4 yield by $113.5 \text{ NL CH}_4 \text{ kg}^{-1} \text{ VS}$, highlighting the benefits of co-digestion for balancing the C/N and diluting inhibitory compounds.

The lower CH_4 yields obtained in this study can be attributed to several factors. First, the single-stage configuration may have limited the hydrolysis and acidogenesis of the FW, as the optimal conditions for these processes differ from those for methanogenesis. Srimachai et al. (2025) demonstrated that a two-stage system (CSTR-PFR or CSTR-CSTR) can enhance CH_4 production by separating the hydrogen producing and CH_4 -producing phases. Second, the C-GL impurities may have inhibited methanogenic activity. Anand and Saxena (2012) reported that C-GL from biodiesel production contains impurities such as methanol, soaps, and free fatty acids that can inhibit microbial growth and fermentation. Third, the VFA/Alk fluctuated from 0.3 to 1.2, indicating potential process instability. Ribas et al. (2007) emphasised the importance of accurate VFA and Alk measurements for timely detection of process imbalance. Fourth, the fungal contamination observed during the cleaning of the reactor may have competed with methanogens for substrate, potentially reducing CH_4 production. Degueurce et al. (2020) reported that storage of FW can lead to the growth of fungi and other microorganisms that consume organic matter and produce inhibitory compounds.

Despite the lower yields, the results demonstrate that CH_4 production was maintained throughout the experimental period, confirming the technical feasibility of co-digesting FW and C-GL in a single-stage system. The specific CH_4 yield during the co-digestion phase ($19.71 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}$) was lower than during the adaptation phase, but the volumetric productivity was higher, indicating that the reactor was able to handle increased OLRs. These findings are consistent with Gebreegziabher et al. (2025), who reported that co-digestion of C-GL with nitrogen-rich substrates such as FW can enhance biogas production by balancing the C/N and providing essential nutrients. However, the accumulation of

VFAs and the decrease in pH observed during the co-digestion phase highlight the need for careful monitoring and control of the OLR. Tomczak et al. (2025) recommended that the C-GL content in the feedstock should not exceed 8 % (v/v) to avoid inhibition, and that the OLR should be adjusted based on the buffering capacity of the system.

Chapter 7

Conclusion

A direct comparison of the co-digestion and C-GL only phases reveals that the co-digestion of FW and C-GL resulted in higher biogas yields and more stable operation. The pH was decreasing faster with the co-digestion, where with C-GL only phase it wasn't decreasing that fast, and was even growing with the KHCO_3 that was added to maintain the pH. These results support the hypothesis that C-GL, when co-digested with FW, can enhance biogas production by balancing the C/N and providing readily available carbon, whereas C-GL alone may work, but would need a different setup and adjustments.

The C-GL only phase, can't be said to be strictly worse than the co-digestion of FW and C-GL, since both phases were done in sequence in the same reactor, this could have given the C-GL phase disadvantages on a contaminated environment.

Using C-GL, with some P-GL to make the necessary adjustment to balance the C/N, could be a viable solution for the C-GL problem. It's only major problem, is that C-GL contains a lot of impurities that can affect the anaerobic digestion, and for a system that can reliably consume it, it will need a better control of it's substrate.

During the whole process, the biggest production of CH_4 was when VFA/Alk was ≈ 1 with a pH of ≈ 6.5 , during the C-GL only phase, even with not optimal values of pH and VFA/Alk, it was able to maintain a reasonable amount of production of CH_4 , showing that it can be a suitable substrate for AD.

The CH_4 yield obtained ($28.96 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}$) is lower than values reported in the literature for similar co-digestion systems. The highest volumetric productivity ($0.0446 \text{ L L}_r^{-1} \text{ d}^{-1}$) was observed during the co-digestion phase, while the highest specific yield ($45.64 \text{ NmL CH}_4 \text{ g}^{-1} \text{ VS}_{\text{fed}}$) occurred during the adaptation phase. This shows how importance of controlling the OLR, VFA/Alk and the amount of C-GL used to enhance the CH_4 production.

Future studies could involve on how to use better the C-GL as a feed, to try subside it's downside of it's impurities and need for an extra carbon rich substrate to balance the feed.

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